Submitted to Statistical Science

Generalized Jeffreys's approximate objective Bayes factor: Model-selection consistency, finite-sample accuracy, and the Jeffreys-Lindley Paradox in early-phase clinical trials

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Abstract.

Concerns about the misuse and misinterpretation of p-values and statistical significance have motivated alternatives for quantifying evidence. We define a generalized form of Jeffreys's approximate objective Bayes factor ($eJAB$), a one-line calculation that is a function of the p-value, sample size, and dimension of the test. We establish conditions under which $eJAB$ is model-selection consistent and verify them for common statistical tests as well as through empirical analysis of several replication studies. We assess finite-sample approximation accuracy by comparing $eJAB$ with Markov chain Monte Carlo computed Bayes factors. Simulation studies compare the decision error probabilities of $eJAB$ with test-statistic Bayes factors (TSBF; Johnson, 2005; Johnson, Pramanik and Shudde, 2023), BIC approximations, and classical NHST. We also discuss a modification of $eJAB$ for one-sided tests and establish its model selection consistency. An exploratory reanalysis of 16,563 findings from 1,790 early-phase ClinicalTrials.gov trials yields 11 numerical reports and nine censored bounds under an eJAB > 3 screen; we examine their hypothesis contexts to identify illustrative Jeffreys–Lindley disagreements.

Key words and phrases: Jeffreys's approximate objective Bayes factor, Jeffreys–Lindley paradox, null-hypothesis significance testing, p-values, replicability.

1. INTRODUCTION

Concerns about the replicability of scientific findings, arising in part from the overreliance on null-hypothesis significance testing (NHST) at conventional p-value thresholds (Ioannidis, 2005), have prompted calls for more stringent standards of evidence (Benjamin et al., 2018; Johnson, 2013), more judicious interpretation of statistical significance (Wasserstein and Lazar, 2016), and alternative measures for quantifying statistical evidence (Berger and Sellke, 1987; Evans, 2016; Grün-

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wald, 2024; Halsey, 2019). One such measure is the Bayes factor—the ratio of marginal likelihoods under competing hypotheses (Kass and Raftery, 1995; Kass and Wasserman, 1995; Ly, Verhagen and Wagenmakers, 2016; Morey, Romeijn and Rouder, 2016; Raftery, 1995; Wagenmakers, 2007). The evidential behavior of p-values and Bayes factors has been studied through stochastic ordering in sample size and effect size, with implications for the Jeffreys–Lindley paradox, under which the two approaches can yield conflicting conclusions (Held and Ott, 2016, 2018; Huisman, 2023; Wagenmakers and Ly, 2023; Wei, Nathoo and Masson, 2023). An important practical consideration, however, is the computational complexity of Bayes factors. since they require integration over prior distributions, often via numerical methods such as Markov chain Monte Carlo (MCMC) with model-specific tuning (JASP, 2026; Morey and Rouder, 2026; Sinharay and Stern, 2005). Approximate Bayes factors offer a computationally convenient alternative when exact or full marginal-likelihood calculations are difficult. Such approximations can be derived from asymptotic theory, information criteria, p-values and test statistics, or summary statistics.

In an early but underappreciated contribution, Jeffreys (1936) developed an approximate Bayes factor, referred to here as JAB, for testing a point-null hypothesis against a composite alternative under a normal unit-information prior centered at the maximum likelihood estimate (MLE). The resulting expression contains the Wald statistic in the exponential term and the effective sample size in a square-root term. Through a detailed reexamination of Jeffreys's work, Wagenmakers (2022) further simplified the exponential component using a piecewise approximation to the quantile function associated with the Wald statistic in JAB. The finite-sample form depends on the prior centering; for the one-sided construction below, we use a symmetric local prior centered at the null value. A one-sided version of JAB can then be obtained by multiplying the two-sided JAB by a factor reflecting the posterior mass assigned to the theoretically predicted direction (Marsman and Wagenmakers, 2017). More recently, Wagenmakers, Bartoš and Aust (2026) showed that, for single-parameter Wald-type tests, certain forms of JAB can be interpreted as approximate e-processes. Because e-processes support sequential monitoring and optional stopping while controlling the probability of accumulating misleading evidence against the null hypothesis, this connection suggests that JAB may also possess useful approximate frequentist error-control properties in sequential settings.

Another influential approximation is based on the Bayesian information criterion (BIC). For single-parameter tests, the Bayes factor approximation is asymptotically equivalent to JAB, with the likelihood-ratio test statistic replacing the Wald statistic. A related refinement is proposed by Bickel (2025), which incorporates a finite sample-size correction term into the BIC by raising the likelihood ratio to a correction-dependent power, thereby reducing evidential exaggeration under the null hypothesis.

An alternative line of research develops test-statistic Bayes factors (TSBFs) in closed form from the sampling distributions of test statistics under local alternatives, rather than treating them as approximations to full data Bayes factors (Johnson, 2005, 2008; Yuan and Johnson, 2008). More recently, the Bayes factor function has retained this core structure as a family of TSBFs evaluated over alternative hypotheses indexed by a standardized effect size, while extending the class of nonlocal priors used to define these alternatives (Datta et al., 2025a,b; Johnson, Pramanik and Shudde, 2023). For each fixed nonzero effect size, the resulting Bayes factor function is pointwise model-selection consistent.

Building on these developments, we derive an extended version of JAB, hereafter *eJAB*, using the Savage–Dickey density ratio representation under a generalized unit-information prior. This extension incorporates parameter dimension, accounts for finite-sample corrections, and facilitates applications to nonparametric testing. Our work differs from Bickel (2025) in its consideration of p-values beyond those from the likelihood ratio test and in our explicit statement of conditions for model-selection consistency. For the latter, Bickel (2025) demonstrates asymptotic equivalence to the BIC so that model-selection consistency arises under the conditions specified in Neath and Cavanaugh (2012). Our work also differs from Bartoš and Wagenmakers (2023), Rostgaard (2023), and Wagenmakers (2022) primarily in the formulation of the generalization and the development of its theoretical justification. We assess the finite-sample performance of *eJAB* across ten common parametric and nonparametric tests. The results suggest that *eJAB* is a broadly applicable and reliable approach to approximate the Bayes factor. We then apply *eJAB* to 16,563 reported primary- and secondary-outcome findings from 1,790 early phase I, phase I, and phase II trials registered on https://ClinicalTrials.gov (CTG), accessed on August 7th, 2025. An eJAB > 3 screen yields 20 records, whose numerical reports, censored bounds, and hypothesis contexts are documented in Supplementary Table S3.

2. METHODOLOGY

DEFINITION 2.1. To test the hypotheses $\mathcal{H}_0 : \boldsymbol{\theta} = \boldsymbol{\theta}_0$ versus $\mathcal{H}_1 : \boldsymbol{\theta} \neq \boldsymbol{\theta}_0$, we define *eJAB* as

$$eJAB_{01} = \sqrt{n}\exp\left\{-\frac{1}{2}\frac{n^{1/q}-1}{n^{1/q}}\,Q_{\chi^2_q}(1-p)\right\},$$

where q is the dimension of the test, n is the sample size, $Q_{\chi^2_q}(\cdot)$ is the quantile function of the chi-squared distribution with q degrees of freedom (df), and p is the p-value from an NHST. We further define $eJAB_{10} = 1\,/\,eJAB_{01}$.

DEFINITION 2.2. For a scalar right-sided test of $\mathcal{H}_0 : \theta = \theta_0$ versus $\mathcal{H}_+ : \theta > \theta_0$, let p_1 denote the one-sided p-value and define $p = 2\min\{p_1, 1-p_1\}$. The corresponding $eJAB$ is given by

$$eJAB_{0+} = \frac{\sqrt{n}}{2(1-p_1)}\exp\left\{-\frac{1}{2}Q_{\chi^2_1}(1-p)\right\}.$$

The left-sided test is handled analogously.

THEOREM 2.3. *Assuming the NHST p-value satisfies two regularity conditions,*

- ***R1***: $p \xrightarrow{D} \text{Unif}(0,1)$ *as* $n \to \infty$ *under* $\mathcal{H}_0$,
- ***R2***: $D_n = -\sqrt{n}\cdot p\ln p \xrightarrow{P} 0$ *as* $n \to \infty$ *under* $\mathcal{H}_1$,

then,

$$\operatorname*{plim}_{n\to\infty} eJAB_{01} = \begin{cases} \infty & \text{under } \mathcal{H}_0, \\ 0 & \text{under } \mathcal{H}_1. \end{cases}$$

The proof is provided in Appendix D.

When $q = 1$, the two $eJAB$ definitions are related by

$$eJAB_{0+} = \frac{n^{\frac{1}{2(1-n)}}}{2(1-p_1)}\,eJAB_{01}^{\frac{n}{n-1}}.$$

Under $\mathcal{H}_0$, **R1** implies $eJAB_{01} \xrightarrow{P} \infty$. Since $n^{\frac{1}{2(1-n)}} \to 1$ and $(2(1-p_1))^{-1} \geq 1/2$, we have $eJAB_{0+} \xrightarrow{P} \infty$. Under $\mathcal{H}_+$, **R2** implies $eJAB_{01} \xrightarrow{P} 0$. Assuming additionally **R3**: $(1-p_1)^{-1} = \mathcal{O}_p(1)$ under $\mathcal{H}_+$, it follows that $eJAB_{0+} \xrightarrow{P} 0$. Therefore, the one-sided $eJAB$ is also model-selection consistent.

FACT. We can derive $eJAB$ as an approximation using a generalization of the multivariate normal unit-information prior for the parameters under test,

$$\boldsymbol{\theta} \sim \boldsymbol{\mathcal{N}}_q\left(\hat{\boldsymbol{\theta}},\ n^{1/q}\cdot\mathbf{J}_n^{-1}(\hat{\boldsymbol{\theta}})\right),$$

where $\hat{\boldsymbol{\theta}}$ is the MLE, and $\mathbf{J}_n(\hat{\boldsymbol{\theta}})$ is the observed information matrix of size $q \times q$. Under an asymptotic Gaussian approximation, the posterior density takes the form, $\pi(\boldsymbol{\theta} \mid \boldsymbol{y}, \mathcal{H}_1) \approx$

$$(2\pi)^{-\frac{q}{2}}|\mathbf{J}_n(\hat{\boldsymbol{\theta}})|^{\frac{1}{2}}\exp\left\{-\frac{1}{2}(\boldsymbol{\theta}-\hat{\boldsymbol{\theta}})^\top\cdot\mathbf{J}_n(\hat{\boldsymbol{\theta}})\cdot(\boldsymbol{\theta}-\hat{\boldsymbol{\theta}})\right\}.$$

Assuming that the prior density for any nuisance parameters under $\mathcal{H}_0$ is everywhere equal to the conditional prior density for those parameters under $\mathcal{H}_1$, given the null value of the parameter under test, the Bayes factor (BF) can be expressed as the Savage–Dickey density ratio (Mulder, Wagenmakers and Marsman, 2022),

$$BF_{01} = \frac{\pi(\boldsymbol{\theta}_0 \mid \boldsymbol{y}, \mathcal{H}_1)}{\pi(\boldsymbol{\theta}_0 \mid \mathcal{H}_1)} \approx \sqrt{n}\exp\left\{-\frac{1}{2}\frac{n^{1/q}-1}{n^{1/q}}W\right\},$$

where $\boldsymbol{y}$ represents the data, and W is the Wald statistic. When the p-value is obtained from a Wald test, substituting $W = Q_{\chi^2_q}(1-p)$ yields $eJAB_{01}$ in Definition 2.1.

The prior underlying the approximate BF interpretation is centered around the MLE $\hat{\boldsymbol{\theta}}$ with $|\text{Var}(\boldsymbol{\theta})| = n\,|\mathbf{J}_n^{-1}(\hat{\boldsymbol{\theta}})|$. When $q = 1$, this is the unit-information prior. More generally, the volume of prior probability ellipsoids around the MLE is $\mathcal{O}(n^{(1-q)/2})$. The prior distribution is asymptotically diffuse relative to the likelihood.

Setting $a_n = n^{\frac{1}{q}}$ yields $\sqrt{n}$ growth in the evidence for $\mathcal{H}_0$, so that under eJAB the rate of evidence accumulation with sample size towards $\mathcal{H}_0$ is independent of the dimension q. When $q > 1$ (F- and chi-squared tests) and effect sizes are small, this avoids the overly conservative behavior of the BIC approximation to the Bayes factor in favor of the null hypothesis (as detailed in the `R` Markdown files in the GitHub Simulations directory), while retaining model-selection consistency under R1 and R2.

FACT. When the p-value is obtained from a likelihood ratio test and $q = 1$, $eJAB$ reduces to the evidential BIC method of Bickel (2025). This approximation is derived by applying a finite-sample correction to the BIC approximation to the BF, which amounts to raising the likelihood ratio to the power $(n-1)/n$. Model-selection consistency for the evidential BIC follows from its asymptotic equivalence to BIC together with standard consistency results for BIC (Bickel, 2025; Neath and Cavanaugh, 2012). By contrast, the conditions of Theorem 2.3 are broadly applicable: they cover nonparametric tests, provided **R1** and **R2** hold.

FACT. Applying the directional correction of Wagenmakers (2022, pp. 20–22) yields Definition 2.2. Unlike the MLE-centered prior used in the two-sided $eJAB$ (Definition 2.1, $q = 1$), we use a symmetric local prior centered at θ_0, thereby eliminating the $(n-1)/n$ factor in the exponent of $eJAB_{0+}$. The directional correction uses a prior probability of $1/2$ and an approximate posterior probability of $1 - p_1$ in the direction of the alternative, assuming a relatively vague local prior and moderate sample sizes. Appendix C.5 provides implementation details for the clinical-trial analysis.

3. SIMULATION STUDIES

We conduct 12 simulation studies across ten parametric and nonparametric tests to evaluate the regularity conditions and finite-sample accuracy. For each design, 5,000 datasets are generated under the null hypothesis and the alternative hypothesis with small, medium, and large effect sizes across various sample sizes. The designs include:

1. Two-sample t-test;
2. Simple linear regression;
3. Simple logistic regression;
4. One-way analysis of variance (ANOVA);
5. One-way repeated-measures ANOVA (rANOVA) with high and low intraclass correlations $\rho \in \{.9, .2\}$;
6. Chi-squared tests for independence under multinomial (total count fixed) and product-multinomial (row counts fixed) designs;
7. Cox proportional-hazards regression with right censoring;
8. Wilcoxon signed-rank test;
9. Mann–Whitney U-test;
10. Kruskal–Wallis H-test.

For nonparametric tests (items 8 through 10), we simulated using right-skewed and heavy-tailed (non-Gaussian) distributions. Detailed simulation settings, additional designs (e.g., two-way ANOVA and large contingency tables), and the `R` code for the subsequent subsections are available in the GitHub repository (see files within 'Theorem', 'Simulations' [parametric], and 'Supplementary Information' [nonparametric]).

We used p-values from the t-test for items 1 and 2; the F-test for items 4 and 5; the Wald test for items 3 and 7; and the asymptotic null distribution for item 6. The p-values for 8–10 are based on asymptotic distributions. The effective sample size n was taken as the number of uncensored observations for survival analysis (Volinsky and Raftery, 2000) and as the number of independent observations (i.e., the product of the number of participants and one less than the number of conditions) for rANOVA (Masson, 2011; Nathoo and Masson, 2016). For the other designs, n always refers to the total number of observations or counts. Among the tests with multiple df ($q > 1$) are items 4 through 6, and 10.

3.1 Verifying the Regularity Conditions

Condition **R1** of Theorem 2.3 is satisfied whenever the p-value is computed from an exact or asymptotic null distribution with a continuous cumulative distribution function.

It is not difficult to verify that **R2** is insufficient to ensure model-selection consistency of the BIC approximation to the BF,

$$BF_{01}^{(\mathrm{BIC})} = n^{\frac{q}{2}} \exp\left\{-\frac{1}{2} Q_{\chi^2_q}(1-p)\right\}.$$

Using the asymptotic expansion of the incomplete gamma function (e.g., Daouia, Stupfler and Usseglio-Carleve, 2025, Lemma A.2), $\frac{1}{2} Q_{\chi^2_q}(1-p) = -\ln p + (\frac{q}{2} - 1)\ln(-\ln p) - \ln\Gamma(\frac{q}{2}) + o(1)$. It follows that $BF_{01}^{(\mathrm{BIC})} \approx \Gamma(\frac{q}{2})\, n^{\frac{q}{2}} \cdot p\,(-\ln p)^{1-\frac{q}{2}}$, which requires a substantially stronger condition than **R2** for model-selection consistency when $q > 1$. Farouk: perhaps more theoretical discussion from the response to reviewers is warranted here?

Puneet: The R2 simulations from the last version should be discussed and put into supplement - those were really good! We also examine **R2** empirically, using realized values of D_n from four large-scale replication projects for results whose original study and every replication attempt reached $p \leq 0.005$, for which we assume $\mathcal{H}_1$ is true. Appendix E of the Supplementary Material describes the study; based on the realized value at the largest sample size, **R2** seems feasible.

3.2 Accuracy of the Bayes-Factor Approximation

To assess the finite-sample accuracy of an approximation to the BF, we compared *eJAB* with alternative computations in seven studies based on the parametric designs, using fixed representative sample sizes. In this subsection, item 7 represents a parametric survival regression model with an exponential baseline and expected censoring fractions of 23% under the null, and 21%, 19%, and 18% under increasing effect sizes. The MCMC-based BFs were computed by sampling the marginal posterior density using '*rstan*' (Stan, 2025), applying logspline density estimation (Kooperberg and Stone, 1992), and calculating the Savage–Dickey density ratio. In these cases, the model underlying the MCMC sampler assumed the same prior as *eJAB*, so discrepancies reflect errors of approximation rather than differences in prior.

Pairs of $(\ln eJAB_{10},\ \ln BF_{10})$ are color- and shape-coded by the p-value. Overall, *eJAB* tracks the MCMC-based BFs closely in Figure 1. Some inaccuracy, $\ln eJAB_{10} < \ln BF_{10}$, appears for logistic regression when evidence favors $\mathcal{H}_1$. Replacing *eJAB* with the BIC approximation to the BF performs well when $q = 1$, but marked severe discrepancies for $q > 1$, indicating that *eJAB* better approximates BF for ANOVA and rANOVA.

In sum, *eJAB* provides an accurate approximation to Bayes factors across a range of designs and effect sizes for parametric tests.

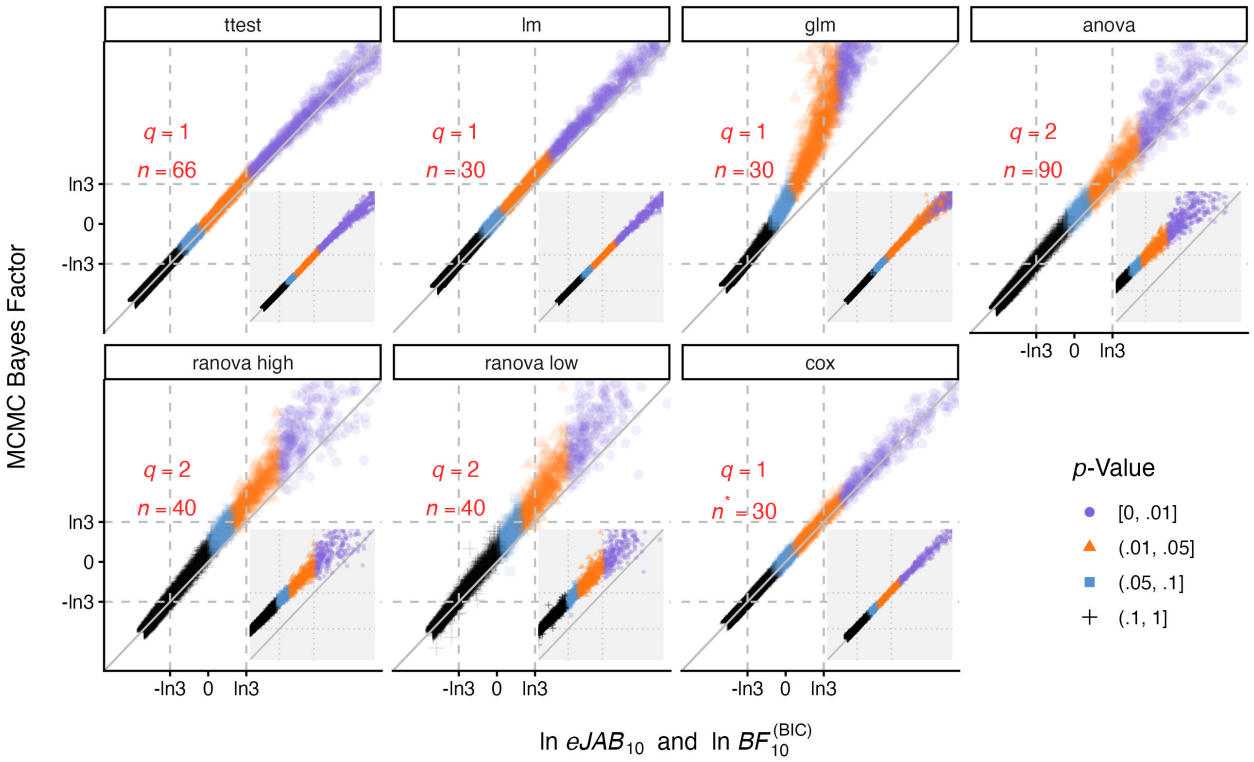


FIG 1. Comparison of the natural logarithms of $eJAB_{10}$ (main plots) and the BIC approximation (gray-background insets) with the MCMC-based Bayes factor. Red text indicates the test dimension q and effective sample size n, except for the Cox model, for which n^* denotes the number of observations rather than the number of events. Colors and shapes represent descriptive p-value intervals; NHST decisions use $p \leq \alpha$. Dashed lines indicate Bayes factors of 1/3 and 3.

3.3 Bayesian Hypothesis Tests Using Nonparametric Statistics

Classical nonparametric tests do not specify a sampling distribution for the data, so marginal likelihoods are not defined. As such, the Bayes factor can be defined based on the marginal likelihood of the test statistic rather than on the data (Yuan and Johnson, 2008). We compared *eJAB* with Bayes factors constructed from nonparametric statistics (*BFNP*) across items 8 through 10. Figures depicting these results, a detailed description of the experiments, and the associated R Markdown files are available in the GitHub repository (see the 'Supplementary Information' directory).

Under $\mathcal{H}_1$, when effects and samples are both relatively small, *BFNP* tends to provide stronger evidence for $\mathcal{H}_1$ than *eJAB*. With larger effects or larger samples, the two methods produce comparable results. Under $\mathcal{H}_0$, *eJAB* effectively quantifies evidence for $\mathcal{H}_0$.

3.4 Equally Weighted Decision Error Profiles

For each effect size θ and sample size n, we compare a simple null (effect zero) with a simple alternative (effect θ). Under 0–1 loss, the equally weighted decision error (EWDE) for decision rule d is

$$\text{EWDE}_d(\theta, n) = \frac{\alpha_d(\theta, n) + \beta_d(\theta, n)}{2},$$

where α_d is the type I error probability under the null and β_d is the type II error probability at the specified alternative, equal to one minus power. Define $\Delta E = \text{EWDE}_{\text{comparison}} - \text{EWDE}_{\text{eJAB}}$. The profiles display the normalized EWDE comparison,

$$\text{EWDE}_{\text{norm}}(\theta, n) = \frac{\Delta E(\theta, n)}{M},$$

where $M = \max_{(\theta,n)\in\mathcal{G}} |\Delta E(\theta, n)|$ and $\mathcal{G}$ is the displayed grid for each panel. Positive values favor eJAB; negative values favor the comparison rule. Figure 2 compares *eJAB* with the $p \leq .005$ rule (A), the BIC Bayes-factor approximation (B), and true- and estimated-effect TSBF rules (C–D). Panel B uses $BF_{01}^{\text{BIC}} = n^{q/2}\exp(-\Lambda/2)$, where Λ is the fitted likelihood-ratio statistic, across the six parametric-likelihood tests with available BIC comparisons. Cox regression and the three rank tests are excluded from this panel. Panel C uses the true standardized effect ω with $\tau_\omega^2 = n\omega^2/q$. For Panel D, $\hat{\omega} = \sqrt{X^2/n}$ and $\hat{\tau}^2 = X^2/q$, where X^2 is the observed chi-squared statistic. The standalone

$p \leq .05$ comparison is provided in Supplementary Figure S3 (Appendix B).

Farouk: Add the new descriptions from the Response Document.

Dashed curves of the form $\theta = c/\sqrt{n}$ hold $\sqrt{n}\theta$ constant. They preserve the alternative distribution when it depends on n and θ only through that quantity, but need not hold normalized EWDE constant because the *eJAB* threshold also depends on n. eJAB, BIC, and TSBF reject $\mathcal{H}_0$ for $BF_{01} < 1$ (not ties); NHST uses $p \leq \alpha$. Under fixed priors, equal model probabilities and 0–1 loss, threshold 1 minimizes prior-predictive error, but need not minimize EWDE. The estimated-effect TSBF is a plug-in sensitivity analysis.

4. THE JEFFREYS–LINDLEY PARADOX IN EARLY-PHASE CLINICAL TRIALS

We apply *eJAB* to ClinicalTrials.gov (CTG) results to illustrate the Jeffreys–Lindley paradox: a conventionally significant result can coexist with evidence favoring a point null under the specified Bayes-factor approximation.

We analyze 16,563 primary- and secondary-outcome CTG findings from 1,790 early-phase trials.

We computed the applicable *eJAB* from each finding's p-value, sample size, and test dimension (Definitions 2.1 and 2.2). NHST significance required $p_1 \leq .025$ for one-sided tests and $p \leq .05$ for two-sided/unrestricted tests. Preprocessing and exclusion criteria are described in Appendices A and C (Miron, Gonçalves and Musen, 2020).

Supplementary Figure S8 plots $\ln eJAB_{01}$ against the two-sided p-value, using $p = 2\min\{p_1, 1-p_1\}$ for one-sided tests. We screen for NHST significance in the specified test direction together with applicable eJAB > 3. For an appropriate point-null test with a numerically reported p-value, this is an illustration compatible with the Jeffreys–Lindley paradox under eJAB.

The screening catalogue includes 11 records with numerically reported p-values, all from five Phase II trials. Table 1 presents the ten largest calculated eJAB values among these records. The complete screening catalogue is provided in Supplementary Table S3 (Appendix C.7).

EJ: "The fact that such conflicts now go entirely unnoticed seems unproductive."

TABLE 1

Ten largest calculated eJAB values among records in the Jeffreys–Lindley screening catalogue with numerically reported p-values, in descending order.

Outcome and analysis	p	eJAB
J05 NCT00565812		Phase II
Number of Participants With Joint Space Narrowing Progression *Logistic regression*; $n = 848$	0.047	**4.06**
J19 NCT05013008		Phase II
Plasma biomarker change: CCN family member 4 (O95388) *t-test*; $n = 921$	0.044	4.00
J20 NCT05013008		Phase II
Plasma biomarker change: TGF beta-1 proprotein (P01137) *t-test*; $n = 921$	0.044	4.00
J06 NCT01225822		Phase II
Major bleeding events: BIBR 1048 50 mg twice daily versus enoxaparin 40 mg daily *Logistic regression*; $n = 781$	0.0472	**3.91**
J18 NCT04376684		Phase II
Part 1: Percentage of Participants Alive and Free of Respiratory Failure at Day 28 *Logistic regression*; $n = 782$	0.0456	3.80
J09 NCT01225822		Phase II
VTE events and all-cause mortality: BIBR 1048 150 mg twice daily versus enoxaparin 40 mg daily *Logistic regression*; $n = 757$	0.0401	**3.36**
J10 NCT01225822		Phase II
VTE events: BIBR 1048 150 mg twice daily versus enoxaparin 40 mg daily *Logistic regression*; $n = 757$	0.0401	3.36
J08 NCT01225822		Phase II
Proximal DVT, pulmonary embolism and VTE-related mortality: BIBR 1048 225 mg versus 50 mg, both twice daily *Logistic regression*; $n = 753$	0.0373	3.15
J04 NCT00565812		Phase II
Number of Participants With Decrease in Total Analgesic Medication Use *Logistic regression*; $n = 971$	0.032	3.13
J03 NCT00405821		Phase II
HIV-1 Viral Load Difference Between Arms *t-test*; $n = 440$	0.05	3.09

5. CONCLUSIONS

eJAB can be interpreted as an approximate objective Bayes factor when p-values are obtained from Wald or likelihood-ratio tests. The same interpretation should hold for tests whose statistics differ from the Wald statistic by $o_p(1)$. Simulations suggest that this interpretation holds more broadly. In addition, *eJAB* remains model-selection consistent for p-values from any test satisfying **R1** and **R2** of Theorem 2.3.

We compared the finite-sample performance of *eJAB* with Bayes factors computed from MCMC and the Savage–Dickey density ratio for the t-test, linear regression, logistic regression, ANOVA, rANOVA, and parametric survival analysis. Under the same generalization of the unit-information prior, *eJAB* closely approximates the MCMC-based Bayes factor. For a chi-

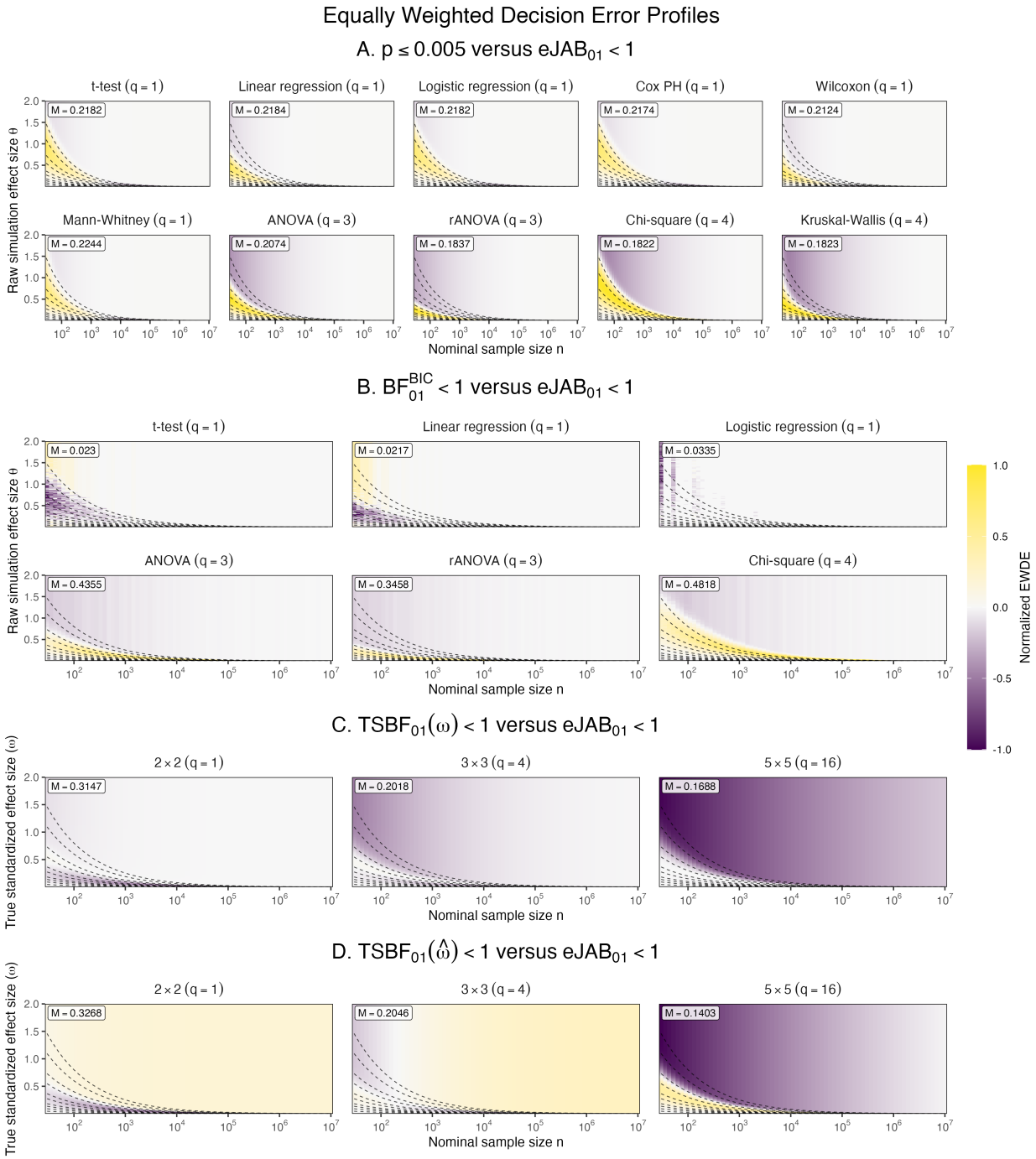


FIG 2. Equally Weighted Decision Error Profiles. (A) $p \leq .005$ versus $eJAB_{01} < 1$ across ten statistical tests. (B) $BF_{01}^{\mathrm{BIC}} < 1$ versus $eJAB_{01} < 1$ across six parametric-likelihood tests. (C) $TSBF_{01}(\omega) < 1$ versus $eJAB_{01} < 1$ and (D) $TSBF_{01}(\hat{\omega}) < 1$ versus $eJAB_{01} < 1$, with $\hat{\omega} = \sqrt{X^2/n}$, for 2×2, 3×3, and 5×5 contingency tables. Colors indicate normalized EWDE: positive values (yellow) favor eJAB, whereas negative values (purple) favor the comparison rule. Each panel reports its normalization constant M, the maximum absolute EWDE difference over its displayed grid. Dashed curves represent local alternatives of the form $\theta = c/\sqrt{n}$, with $\theta = \omega$ for the contingency-table comparisons.

squared test under multinomial or product-multinomial sampling, it agrees with the test-statistic Bayes factor under the alternative, unlike the latter, also registers evidence for the null when true. For nonparametric tests, namely Wilcoxon signed-rank, Mann–Whitney, and Kruskal–Wallis, *eJAB* performs comparably to Bayes factors based on nonparametric test statistics. Our simulations also show improved performance compared to the BIC approximation to the Bayes factor when $q > 1$.

The Equally Weighted Decision Error Profiles compare *eJAB* with true- and estimated-effect TSBFs, BIC approximations, and NHST significance rules. Relative performance varies with sample size, effect size, and dimension; the comparisons do not establish uniform decision-error dominance.

Screening for the disagreement eJAB > 3 yields 11 numerical-report records and nine records based on censored p-values; the latter, including four equivalence-context records, do not establish point-null paradox instances. The documented examples illustrate how statistical significance and Bayesian evidence can disagree under a specified approximation. They motivate scrutiny of individual hypotheses and reported analyses rather than identifying type I errors or explaining later clinical-trial failures.

ACKNOWLEDGMENTS

The authors would like to thank one reviewer for his detailed recommendations on clarifying the prior specification and regularity conditions, examining connections with test-statistic Bayes factors and local alternatives, and strengthening the scope, methodological justification, and presentation of the clinical-trial analysis. The authors would like to thank another reviewer for his constructive assessment of the method's practical relevance, his perspective on interpreting conflicts between statistical significance and Bayesian evidence, and his encouragement to improve the manuscript's accessibility. The authors would like to thank the Associate Editor for synthesizing the reviewers' concerns and highlighting the theoretical and applied issues requiring particular attention in the revision.

FUNDING

This work was supported by a discovery grant to Farouk S. Nathoo (RGPIN-04044-2020) from the Natural Sciences and Engineering Research Council of Canada and research accelerator awards to Puneet Velidi and Yimeng Liu from the Maud Menten Institute.

SUPPLEMENTARY MATERIAL

Appendices A–H provide supplementary methods and results. The Online Supplement, data, and code are available in the GitHub repository. An online *eJAB* calculator is also available.

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